

Theoretical Review of Josephson Parametric Amplifiers

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Abstract—This paper presents a detailed theoretical review of the amplification process in Josephson Parametric Amplifiers (JPAs), which are crucial for quantum-limited signal amplification in superconducting circuits [1, 2]. The paper begins by outlining the principles of parametric amplification, focusing on how a strong classical pump interacts with the nonlinear Josephson medium in reflection geometry. The key dynamical equations under intense pumping, leading to a nonlinear steady-state solution, are derived [1]. Linearizing around this solution allows to analyze the system response to weak signals and extract expressions for parametric gain and intermodulation gain using the input-output formalism [3, 4]. Numerically, these equations are solved to explore how gain depends on frequency detuning and pump strength, visualizing the results with gain plots. This work contributes to a deeper understanding of JPAs to motivate future research in quantum-limited amplification.

I. MOTIVATION

Josephson Parametric Amplifiers (JPAs) are essential for amplifying weak microwave signals with near quantum limited noise performance an ability critical for high-fidelity readout in quantum information processing. Unlike conventional amplifiers such as HEMTs, JPAs offer high gain (often >20dB) [1] with tunable frequency and gain, enabling selective signal amplification with minimal added noise. JPAs are crucial in superconducting qubit readout, allowing single-shot measurements, and they also enable the generation and detection of squeezed microwave states, important for quantum metrology [5, 6]. Their non-dissipative Josephson nonlinearity underpins efficient parametric amplification, setting them apart from other devices with lossy nonlinearities. Additionally, JPAs are compact, on-chip components, easily integrated into superconducting circuits—an advantage for scalable quantum computing. Beyond applications, they offer insight into nonlinear quantum dynamics, bistability, and quantum noise squeezing, making them valuable both technologically and fundamentally.

II. WHAT IS A JPA

The Josephson Parametric Amplifier is a superconducting quantum-limited amplifier that uses the nonlinear inductance of Josephson junctions to amplify microwave signals. These amplifiers are critical components in quantum computing and measurement systems, particularly for reading out qubits with minimal added noise [5]. A quantum-limited amplifier adds the minimum possible noise allowed by quantum mechanics to a signal during amplification. This is a fundamental limit, not due to imperfections, but imposed by the Heisenberg uncertainty principle. The term 'parametric' refers to a system in which some parameter (such as the refractive index or impedance) is being varied over time, often by an external pump field. In both optical and microwave circuits, this external modulation leads to energy being transferred between different frequency modes, typically creating or amplifying photons.

In a non-linear optical medium, the polarization $\mathbf{P}$ (response of the material to an electric field $\mathbf{E}$) is not proportional to the field. It includes higher-order terms in the electric field:

$$\mathbf{P} = \epsilon_0 \left(\chi^{(1)} \mathbf{E} + \chi^{(2)} \mathbf{E}^2 + \chi^{(3)} \mathbf{E}^3 + \dots \right) \quad (1)$$

- $\chi^{(2)}$: leads to three-wave mixing
- $\chi^{(3)}$: leads to four-wave mixing

While the second-order nonlinear susceptibility $\chi^{(2)}$ is nonzero only in materials that lack inversion symmetry, Josephson junctions can emulate an effective $\chi^{(2)}$ like interaction through flux modulation. In Three-Wave Mixing ($\chi^{(2)}$) one pump photon (frequency ω_p) is split into the following:

- One signal photon (ω_s)
- One idler photon (ω_i)

The pump photon is a photon from a strong, external electromagnetic field (often a microwave or optical tone). Its role is to "pump" energy into a non-linear system (like a Josephson junction or SQUID), enabling frequency conversion or amplification of weaker signals. It is not the signal that we are trying to amplify — it is the energy source that drives the nonlinear interaction. The pump photon comes from an external generator or oscillator. Energy conservation:

$$\omega_p = \omega_s + \omega_i$$

This process is called Spontaneous Parametric Down-Conversion (SPDC) when the signal and idler fields start in the vacuum state.

In Four-Wave Mixing ($\chi^{(3)}$) two pump photons combine to produce:

- One signal photon (ω_s)
- One idler photon (ω_i)

Energy conservation:

$$2\omega_p = \omega_s + \omega_i$$

This is called Spontaneous Four-Wave Mixing (SFWM) when the signal and idler fields start in vacuum.

In optical systems, nonlinear crystals (with nonlinearity) allow to mix frequencies of light — creating signal and idler photons via processes like SPDC or SFWM. In the microwave regime, we want to do the same — mix or amplify microwave-frequency signals — but we don't have natural nonlinear crystals. Instead, we use engineered quantum circuits, particularly Josephson junctions and SQUIDs, to achieve nonlinearity. These artificial atoms play the role of non-linear media in cQED. We work with photons in the GHz frequency range, which are quantized excitations of the electromagnetic field, much like visible light photons, but at much lower frequencies. Although they are not "light" in the visible sense, they are still electromagnetic in nature. In this context, the concept of refractive index used in optics is replaced by circuit parameters like inductance and

capacitance, which together determine the impedance of superconducting circuits that generate and manipulate these microwave photons. To realize a parametric process in circuits, the impedance needs to be modulated, typically via the inductance, using a Josephson junction. A Josephson junction is a superconducting device with no energy loss and a highly nonlinear current-voltage relationship. The junction has a Josephson inductance given approximately by:

$$L_J(t) \approx \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi I_c \cos(\phi(t))}$$

where:

- $\Phi_0 = \frac{h}{2e}$ is the flux quantum,
- I_c is the critical current,
- $\phi(t)$ is the superconducting phase difference across the junction.

This inductance can be derived from the Josephson relations: $I = I_c \sin \phi$ and $V = \frac{\hbar}{2e} \frac{d\phi}{dt} = \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi} \frac{d\phi(t)}{dt}$. The Josephson inductance $L_J(t)$ is defined by the small-signal linear relation:

$$V(t) = L_J(t) \frac{dI(t)}{dt}$$

Using the current-phase relation:

$$I(t) = I_c \sin \phi(t) \Rightarrow \frac{dI}{dt} = I_c \cos \phi(t) \cdot \frac{d\phi}{dt}$$

From the voltage relation:

$$\frac{d\phi}{dt} = \frac{2\pi}{\Phi_0} V(t)$$

Substitute into the derivative:

$$\frac{dI}{dt} = I_c \cos \phi(t) \cdot \frac{2\pi}{\Phi_0} V(t)$$

Finally,

$$V(t) = \frac{1}{I_c \cos \phi(t)} \cdot \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi} \cdot \frac{dI}{dt}$$

Comparing with $V(t) = L_J(t) \frac{dI}{dt}$, we identify:

$$L_J(t) = \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi I_c \cos \phi(t)}$$

In the small current limit $I(t) \ll I_c$, the inductance can be determined as follows.

We know the cosine of the phase is:

$$\cos \phi(t) = \sqrt{1 - \left(\frac{I(t)}{I_c}\right)^2}$$

Substituting back into the inductance expression:

$$L_J(t) = \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi I_c \sqrt{1 - \left(\frac{I(t)}{I_c}\right)^2}}$$

Defining $x = \frac{I(t)}{I_c}$, and assume $x \ll 1$. Then:

$$L_J(t) = \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi I_c} \cdot \frac{1}{\sqrt{1 - x^2}}$$

Expanding the denominator using the binomial expansion:

$$(1 - x^2)^{-1/2} \approx 1 + \frac{1}{2}x^2 + \frac{3}{8}x^4 + \dots$$

Keeping only the leading nonlinear term:

$$L_J(t) \approx \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi I_c} \left(1 + \frac{1}{2} \left(\frac{I(t)}{I_c} \right)^2 \right)$$

Defining the zero-current (linear) inductance:

$$L_J = \frac{\Phi_0}{2\pi I_c}$$

Then:

$$L_J(t) \approx L_J \left(1 + \frac{1}{2} \left(\frac{I(t)}{I_c} \right)^2 \right) \quad (2)$$

This shows that the inductance depends *nonlinearly* on the current. If the junction is driven with a microwave signal (i.e., an AC current), the inductance becomes time-varying. This implies a time-varying impedance — analogous to a modulated refractive index in optics. This periodic modulation enables four-wave mixing (FWM), in which:

$$\text{Pump} + \text{Pump} \rightarrow \text{Signal} + \text{Idler}$$

In a SQUID, the effective Josephson inductance can be tuned by applying an external magnetic flux $\Phi_{\text{ext}}(t)$ through the loop:

$$L_{\text{SQUID}}(t) \approx L_J \left(1 + \frac{I(t)}{I_0} \right) \quad (3)$$

where:

- $I(t)$ is the AC drive current,
- I_0 depends on the DC flux bias applied to the SQUID loop.

Since the modulation is linear in $I(t)$ (not quadratic), it can support three-wave mixing:

$$\text{Pump} \rightarrow \text{Signal} + \text{Idler}$$

The time-dependent, nonlinear inductance can be used to construct parametric amplifiers, which amplify weak microwave signals by mixing them with a strong pump field. The following description corresponds to four-wave mixing, with the model adapted from [1] and the derivations presented in detail, further supported by a computational study demonstrating 20dB of parametric gain for a JPA.

III. THE HAMILTONIAN

1. Hamiltonian of the Nonlinear Resonator

The Hamiltonian of a nonlinear resonator, with Kerr nonlinearity K , is given by:

$$H_r = \hbar \omega_0 A^\dagger A + \frac{\hbar}{2} K A^\dagger A^\dagger A A \quad (4)$$

Here:

- ω_0 is the resonant frequency of the cavity.
- A and $A^\dagger$ are the annihilation and creation operators of the cavity mode.
- K is the Kerr constant, representing the strength of the nonlinearity.

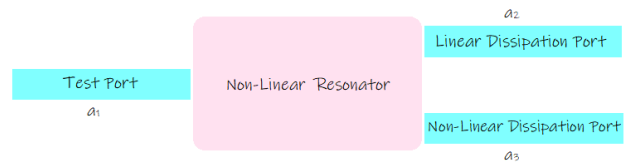


Fig. 1: The model [1]

This Hamiltonian describes a system where the energy levels are not equally spaced due to the Kerr effect, leading to phenomena such as photon blockade and bistability. In this configuration, the resonator operates as an amplifier, where the reflected signal from the input port a_1 is stronger than the incoming signal. This is known as the

negative-resistance reflection mode at microwave frequencies. To model energy dissipation theoretically, two additional fictitious ports are introduced:

- Port a_2 : represents linear (single-photon) dissipation.
- Port a_3 : accounts for nonlinear (two-photon) dissipation and is nonlinearly coupled to the resonator mode A .

2. Total System Hamiltonian

The total Hamiltonian includes the resonator H_r and its interaction with various ports:

$$H = H_r + H_{a1} + H_{a2} + H_{a3} + H_{T1} + H_{T2} + H_{T3} \quad (5)$$

Where:

- H_{a1}, H_{a2}, H_{a3} are the Hamiltonians of the external baths (ports).
- H_{T1}, H_{T2}, H_{T3} are the interaction Hamiltonians between the resonator and the respective ports.

Each bath is modeled as a continuum of harmonic oscillators:

$$H_{a1} = \int d\omega \hbar \omega a_1^\dagger(\omega) a_1(\omega) \quad (6)$$

$$H_{a2} = \int d\omega \hbar \omega a_2^\dagger(\omega) a_2(\omega) \quad (7)$$

$$H_{a3} = \int d\omega \hbar \omega a_3^\dagger(\omega) a_3(\omega) \quad (8)$$

Here, $a_j(\omega)$ and $a_j^\dagger(\omega)$ are the annihilation and creation operators for the bath modes at frequency ω . The interactions between the resonator and the baths are given by:

Linear Coupling (Ports $a1$ and $a2$):

$$H_{T1} = \hbar \int d\omega \left[\kappa_1 A^\dagger a_1(\omega) + \kappa_1^* a_1^\dagger(\omega) A \right] \quad (9)$$

$$H_{T2} = \hbar \int d\omega \left[\kappa_2 A^\dagger a_2(\omega) + \kappa_2^* a_2^\dagger(\omega) A \right] \quad (10)$$

Nonlinear (Two-Photon) Coupling (Port $a3$):

$$H_{T3} = \hbar \int d\omega \left[\kappa_3 A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega) + \kappa_3^* a_3^\dagger(\omega) A A \right] \quad (11)$$

Here, the magnitude $|\kappa_i|$ determines the coupling strength (rate of energy exchange), while the phase of κ_i encodes interference or coherence effects and can be tunable via external parameters such as drive or flux. The parameters κ_1 and κ_2 correspond to the coupling constant for linear couplings between the system and external ports, while κ_3 is the nonlinear (two-photon) coupling constant. The two-photon coupling represents processes where two photons in the resonator are annihilated simultaneously, creating a single photon in the bath.

HEISENBERG EQUATION OF MOTION FOR ANNIHILATION OPERATOR A

We start with the Heisenberg equation of motion:

$$\frac{dA}{dt} = \frac{1}{i\hbar} [A, H] \quad (12)$$

The total Hamiltonian is:

$$H = H_r + H_{a1} + H_{a2} + H_{a3} + H_{T1} + H_{T2} + H_{T3} \quad (13)$$

We know the Resonator Hamiltonian H_r

$$H_r = \hbar \omega_0 A^\dagger A + \frac{\hbar}{2} K A^\dagger A^\dagger A A \quad (14)$$

(a) First term:

$$\begin{aligned} [A, \hbar \omega_0 A^\dagger A] &= \hbar \omega_0 [A, A^\dagger A] \\ &= \hbar \omega_0 ([A, A^\dagger] A + A^\dagger [A, A]) = \hbar \omega_0 A \end{aligned} \quad (15)$$

(b) Second term:

$$\begin{aligned} [A, \frac{\hbar}{2} K A^\dagger A^\dagger A A] &= \frac{\hbar}{2} K [A, A^\dagger A^\dagger A A] \\ &= \frac{\hbar}{2} K \cdot 2 A^\dagger A A = \hbar K A^\dagger A A \end{aligned} \quad (16)$$

So:

$$[A, H_r] = \hbar \omega_0 A + \hbar K A^\dagger A A \quad (17)$$

Commutator with Bath Hamiltonians H_{ai}

$$[A, H_{ai}] = 0 \quad (18)$$

These are integrals over bath-only operators, which commute with A since they're different systems. So these terms do not contribute. Because the bath degrees of freedom act on a different Hilbert space than the system operator A . They're independent systems, so their operators commute.

Commutators with Interaction Hamiltonians

We have three types of Hamiltonians that couple a system operator A to bath modes $a_i(\omega)$. We analyze the commutators $[A, H_{Ti}]$ for each case.

(a) Linear Coupling H_{T1} :

$$H_{T1} = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_1 A^\dagger a_1(\omega) + \kappa_1^* a_1^\dagger(\omega) A \right)$$

We compute:

$$[A, H_{T1}] = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_1 [A, A^\dagger a_1(\omega)] + \kappa_1^* [A, a_1^\dagger(\omega) A] \right)$$

A and $a_1(\omega)$ act on different systems (system vs bath), so they commute:

$$[A, a_1(\omega)] = [A, a_1^\dagger(\omega)] = 0$$

Therefore:

$$[A, A^\dagger a_1(\omega)] = [A, A^\dagger] a_1(\omega) = a_1(\omega)$$

$$[A, a_1^\dagger(\omega) A] = a_1^\dagger(\omega) [A, A] = 0$$

Hence:

$$[A, H_{T1}] = \hbar \int d\omega \kappa_1 a_1(\omega) \quad (19)$$

The system operator A experiences the input from bath 1 linearly through the operator $a_1(\omega)$ with strength κ_1 .

(b) Linear Coupling H_{T2} :

$$H_{T2} = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_2 A^\dagger a_2(\omega) + \kappa_2^* a_2^\dagger(\omega) A \right)$$

In a similar way we compute:

$$[A, H_{T2}] = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_2 [A, A^\dagger a_2(\omega)] + \kappa_2^* [A, a_2^\dagger(\omega) A] \right)$$

$$[A, A^\dagger a_2(\omega)] = [A, A^\dagger] a_2(\omega) = a_2(\omega)$$

$$[A, a_2^\dagger(\omega) A] = 0$$

Therefore:

$$[A, H_{T2}] = \hbar \int d\omega \kappa_2 a_2(\omega) \quad (20)$$

Again, this is a linear coupling from bath 2 into the system.

(c) Nonlinear Coupling H_{T3} :

$$H_{T3} = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_3 A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega) + \kappa_3^* a_3^\dagger(\omega) AA \right)$$

We compute:

$$[A, H_{T3}] = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_3 [A, A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega)] + \kappa_3^* [A, a_3^\dagger(\omega) AA] \right)$$

Since $[A, a_3^\dagger(\omega)] = 0$, the second commutator is zero. So we have:

$$[A, A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega)] = [A, A^\dagger A^\dagger] a_3(\omega)$$

Using the identity $[A, BC] = [A, B]C + B[A, C]$, we get:

$$[A, A^\dagger A^\dagger] = [A, A^\dagger] A^\dagger + A^\dagger [A, A^\dagger] = A^\dagger + A^\dagger = 2A^\dagger$$

Thus:

$$[A, A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega)] = 2A^\dagger a_3(\omega)$$

Putting it together:

$$[A, H_{T3}] = \hbar \int d\omega 2\kappa_3 A^\dagger a_3(\omega) \quad (21)$$

This is a nonlinear input from bath 3. It depends on the system excitation via $A^\dagger$, and the bath input $a_3(\omega)$.

Combining all terms

$$[A, H] = \hbar\omega_0 A + \hbar K A^\dagger AA + \hbar \int d\omega (\kappa_1 a_1(\omega) + \kappa_2 a_2(\omega)) + 2\hbar \int d\omega \kappa_3 A^\dagger a_3(\omega) \quad (22)$$

And dividing both sides by $i\hbar$:

$$\frac{dA}{dt} = -i\omega_0 A - iK A^\dagger AA - i\kappa_1 \int d\omega a_1(\omega) - i\kappa_2 \int d\omega a_2(\omega) - 2i\kappa_3 \int d\omega A^\dagger a_3(\omega) \quad (23)$$

We compute the time evolution of each bath operator in the Heisenberg picture:

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_i(\omega) = \frac{1}{i\hbar} [a_i(\omega), H] \quad (24)$$

We'll do this mode by mode, using the Hamiltonians already given for each interaction.

For $a_1(\omega)$

We need:

$$H_{T1} = \hbar \int d\omega' \left(\kappa_1 A^\dagger a_1(\omega') + \kappa_1^* a_1^\dagger(\omega') A \right)$$

and

$$H_{A1} = \hbar \int d\omega' \omega' a_1^\dagger(\omega') a_1(\omega')$$

So the total Hamiltonian involving $a_1(\omega)$ is:

$$H = H_{A1} + H_{T1} \quad (25)$$

Let's compute the commutator:

(i) Free evolution:

$$[a_1(\omega), H_{A1}] = \hbar \int d\omega' \omega' [a_1(\omega), a_1^\dagger(\omega') a_1(\omega')]$$

Use:

$$[a, a^\dagger b] = [a, a^\dagger] b + a^\dagger [a, b] \Rightarrow [a, a^\dagger b] = \delta a$$

So:

$$[a_1(\omega), a_1^\dagger(\omega') a_1(\omega')] = \delta(\omega - \omega') a_1(\omega') \Rightarrow [a_1(\omega), H_{A1}] = \hbar\omega a_1(\omega)$$

(ii) Interaction term:

$$[a_1(\omega), H_{T1}] = [a_1(\omega), \hbar \int d\omega' \left(\kappa_1 A^\dagger a_1(\omega') + \kappa_1^* a_1^\dagger(\omega') A \right)]$$

Only the second term has nonzero commutator:

$$\begin{aligned} [a_1(\omega), a_1^\dagger(\omega')] &= \delta(\omega - \omega') \\ \Rightarrow [a_1(\omega), H_{T1}] &= \hbar \int d\omega' \kappa_1^* \delta(\omega - \omega') A = \hbar \kappa_1^* A \end{aligned} \quad (26)$$

Therefore:

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_1(\omega) = \frac{1}{i\hbar} [a_1(\omega), H] = -i\omega a_1(\omega) - i\kappa_1^* A \quad (27)$$

For $a_2(\omega)$

Similarly:

$$H_{T2} = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_2 A^\dagger a_2(\omega) + \kappa_2^* a_2^\dagger(\omega) A \right)$$

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_2(\omega) = -i\omega a_2(\omega) - i\kappa_2^* A \quad (28)$$

For $a_3(\omega)$

This bath is nonlinearly coupled:

$$H_{T3} = \hbar \int d\omega \left(\kappa_3 A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega) + \kappa_3^* a_3^\dagger(\omega) AA \right)$$

We compute:

$$[a_3(\omega), H_{T3}] = [a_3(\omega), \hbar \int d\omega' \left(\kappa_3 A^\dagger A^\dagger a_3(\omega') + \kappa_3^* a_3^\dagger(\omega') AA \right)]$$

Only the second term contributes:

$$[a_3(\omega), a_3^\dagger(\omega')] = \delta(\omega - \omega') \Rightarrow [a_3(\omega), H_{T3}] = \hbar \kappa_3^* AA$$

The free part again gives:

$$[a_3(\omega), H_{A3}] = \hbar\omega a_3(\omega)$$

So the final term is:

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_3(\omega) = -i\omega a_3(\omega) - i\kappa_3^* AA \quad (29)$$

QUANTUM LANGEVIN EQUATION DERIVATION

We aim to derive the Quantum Langevin equation for a system operator $A(t)$ linearly coupled to a bosonic bath of harmonic oscillators. This equation will include both a damping term and a noise (input) term.

Heisenberg Equation for Bath Operator $a(\omega, t)$

From the total Hamiltonian, the equation of motion for the bath operator is:

$$\frac{d}{dt} a(\omega, t) = -i\omega a(\omega, t) - i\kappa^* A(t) \quad (30)$$

Solution via Integrating Factor

Multiply Eq. (1) by $e^{i\omega t}$:

$$\begin{aligned} e^{i\omega t} \frac{d}{dt} a(\omega, t) &= -i\omega a(\omega, t) e^{i\omega t} - i\kappa^* A(t) e^{i\omega t} \\ \Rightarrow \frac{d}{dt} [a(\omega, t) e^{i\omega t}] &= -i\kappa^* A(t) e^{i\omega t} \end{aligned}$$

Integrate from t_0 to t :

$$a(\omega, t) e^{i\omega t} - a(\omega, t_0) e^{i\omega t_0} = -i\kappa^* \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A(\tau) e^{i\omega \tau}$$

Multiply by $e^{-i\omega t}$:

$$a(\omega, t) = a(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} - i\kappa^* \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \quad (31)$$

Equation of Motion for the System Operator $A(t)$

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dA}{dt} = & -i\omega_0 A - iKA^\dagger AA - i\kappa_1 \int d\omega a_1(\omega) - i\kappa_2 \int d\omega a_2(\omega) \\ & - 2i\kappa_3 \int d\omega A^\dagger a_3(\omega) \end{aligned} \quad (32)$$

Substituting Eq. (31):

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dA(t)}{dt} = & \dots - i \int d\omega \kappa a(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} \\ & + \int d\omega |\kappa|^2 \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \end{aligned} \quad (33)$$

We define the input field $a_{in}(t)$ as:

$$a_{in}(t) \equiv \frac{1}{2\pi} \int d\omega a(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)}$$

Then Eq. (33) becomes:

$$\frac{dA(t)}{dt} = \dots - i\kappa \cdot 2\pi a_{in}(t) + \int d\omega |\kappa|^2 \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \quad (34)$$

Evaluate the Damping Integral (Markov Approximation)

Assume a broadband bath:

$$\int d\omega e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} = 2\pi\delta(t-\tau) \quad (35)$$

Thus:

$$\int d\omega |\kappa|^2 \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \approx |\kappa|^2 \cdot 2\pi A(t)$$

where we define:

$$\gamma \equiv 2\pi |\kappa|^2 \Rightarrow |\kappa| = \sqrt{\frac{\gamma}{2\pi}} \quad (36)$$

then:

$$\frac{dA(t)}{dt} = \dots - \gamma A(t) - i \cdot 2\pi \kappa a_{in}(t)$$

If $\kappa = \sqrt{\frac{\gamma}{2\pi}} e^{i\phi}$, then:

$$2\pi\kappa = \sqrt{2\pi\gamma} e^{i\phi}$$

Final Langevin Equation

$$\boxed{\frac{dA(t)}{dt} = \dots - \gamma A(t) - i \cdot \sqrt{2\pi\gamma} e^{i\phi} a_{in}(t)} \quad (37)$$

This is the Langevin equation with:

- **Damping term:** $-\gamma A(t)$
- **Noise term:** $-i \cdot \sqrt{2\pi\gamma} e^{i\phi} a_{in}(t)$

This gives us terms for the first two bath modes :

Interaction term	Langevin contribution
$-i\kappa_1 \int d\omega a_1(\omega)$	$-\gamma_1 A(t) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{i\phi_1} a_{in,1}(t)$
$-i\kappa_2 \int d\omega a_2(\omega)$	$-\gamma_2 A(t) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_2} e^{i\phi_2} a_{in,2}(t)$

TABLE I: Langevin contributions from coupling to two bosonic baths.

Similarly we can derive the third term and consequently put all terms together to get the final Langevin equation coupled to 3 different modes.

$$-\gamma_3 A^\dagger AA - i2\sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{i\phi_3} A^\dagger a_3^{in}(t) \quad (38)$$

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{dA}{dt} = & -i\omega_0 A - iKA^\dagger AA - \gamma A - \gamma_3 A^\dagger AA \\ & - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{i\phi_1} a_1^{in}(t) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_2} e^{i\phi_2} a_2^{in}(t) \\ & - i2\sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{i\phi_3} A^\dagger a_3^{in}(t) \end{aligned} \quad (39)$$

Next we derive the relations between the out going bath modes, incoming bath modes and the cavity mode A . Free bath evolution:

$$a_i(\omega, t) = a_i(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} \quad (40)$$

Input field:

$$a_{in,i}(t) = \frac{1}{2\pi} \int d\omega a_i(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} \quad (41)$$

Output field:

$$a_{out,i}(t) = \frac{1}{2\pi} \int d\omega a_i(\omega, t_1) e^{-i\omega(t-t_1)} \quad (42)$$

Solving the Bath Operator EOM :

From the total Hamiltonian, the Heisenberg equation for bath mode i is:

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_i(\omega, t) = -i\omega a_i(\omega, t) - i\kappa_i A(t) \quad (43)$$

This has the solution:

$$a_i(\omega, t) = a_i(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} - i\kappa_i \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \quad (44)$$

Boundary Condition for Mode 1

Using:

$$H_{int,1} = -i\kappa_1 \int d\omega (A^\dagger a_1(\omega) - a_1^\dagger(\omega) A)$$

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_1(\omega, t) = -i\omega a_1(\omega, t) + \kappa_1 A(t) \quad (45)$$

$$a_1(\omega, t_1) = a_1(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t_1-t_0)} + i\kappa_1 \int_{t_0}^{t_1} d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t_1-\tau)} \quad (46)$$

Then plug into the output field:

$$\begin{aligned} a_{out,1}(t) = & \frac{1}{2\pi} \int d\omega \left[a_1(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t_1-t_0)} e^{-i\omega(t-t_1)} \right. \\ & \left. - i\kappa_1 \int_{t_0}^{t_1} d\tau A(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t_1-\tau)} e^{-i\omega(t-t_1)} \right] \\ = & \frac{1}{2\pi} \int d\omega a_1(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} \\ & - i\kappa_1 \int_{t_0}^{t_1} d\tau A(\tau) \left(\frac{1}{2\pi} \int d\omega e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \right) \end{aligned} \quad (47)$$

$$a_{out,1}(t) = a_{in,1}(t) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} A(t) \quad (48)$$

where we identify:

$$\sqrt{\frac{\gamma_1}{\pi}} e^{i\phi_1} = \kappa_1$$

$$\boxed{a_{out,1}(t) - a_{in,1}(t) = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} A(t)} \quad (49)$$

Mode 2 has an identical derivation following a similar procedure:

$$a_{out,2}(t) = a_{in,2}(t) - i2\gamma_2 e^{-i\phi_2} A(t)$$

$$\boxed{a_{out,2}(t) - a_{in,2}(t) = -i2\gamma_2 e^{-i\phi_2} A(t)} \quad (50)$$

Mode 3 — Nonlinear Coupling

Interaction Hamiltonian:

$$H_{int,3} = -i2\kappa_3 \int d\omega A^\dagger a_3(\omega)$$

Heisenberg EOM:

$$\frac{d}{dt} a_3(\omega, t) = -i\omega a_3(\omega, t) + 2\kappa_3 A^\dagger(t) \quad (51)$$

$$a_3(\omega, t) = a_3(\omega, t_0) e^{-i\omega(t-t_0)} + 2\kappa_3 \int_{t_0}^t d\tau A^\dagger(\tau) e^{-i\omega(t-\tau)} \quad (52)$$

Then the output field:

$$a_{out,3}(t) = a_{in,3}(t) - i\sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{-i\phi_3} A(t) A(t)$$

$$a_{\text{out},3}(t) - a_{\text{in},3}(t) = -i\sqrt{\gamma_3}e^{-i\phi_3}A(t)^2 \quad (\text{Eq. 26})$$

Finally,

$$a_{\text{out},1}(t) - a_{\text{in},1}(t) = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}e^{-i\phi_1}A(t) \quad (54)$$

$$a_{\text{out},2}(t) - a_{\text{in},2}(t) = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_2}e^{-i\phi_2}A(t) \quad (55)$$

$$a_{\text{out},3}(t) - a_{\text{in},3}(t) = -i\sqrt{\gamma_3}e^{-i\phi_3}A(t)^2 \quad (56)$$

To determine the device's response to a classical pump without any signal or noise, the incoming noise terms are set to zero. Assumptions:

$$a_{\text{in},2} = 0, \quad a_{\text{in},3} = 0 \quad (57)$$

$$a_{\text{in},1}(t) = b_{\text{in},1}e^{-i(\omega_p t + \psi_1)} \quad \text{where } b_{\text{in},1} \in \mathbb{R} \quad (58)$$

Ansatz for cavity field:

$$A(t) = Be^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)} \quad \text{with } B \in \mathbb{R}_+, \phi_B \in \mathbb{R} \quad (59)$$

Input-Output Relation at Port 1:

$$a_{\text{out},1}(t) - a_{\text{in},1}(t) = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}e^{-i\phi_1}A(t) \quad (60)$$

Substitute ansatz into the EOM. From the ansatz:

$$A(t) = Be^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)}, \quad A^\dagger(t) = Be^{i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)}$$

$$A^\dagger AA = B^3 e^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)}$$

$$\frac{dA}{dt} = -i\omega_p B e^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)} = -i\omega_p A(t)$$

Plug into the EOM (from Eq. (23) under assumptions $a_{\text{in},2} = a_{\text{in},3} = 0$):

$$-i\omega_p A = -i\omega_0 A - iKA^\dagger AA - \gamma A - \gamma_3 A^\dagger AA - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}e^{i\phi_1}a_{\text{in},1}(t)$$

Bring all terms to one side:

$$[i(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + \gamma]A + (iK + \gamma_3)|A|^2 A = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}e^{i\phi_1}a_{\text{in},1}(t)$$

Substitute:

$$A = Be^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)}, \quad |A|^2 = B^2, \quad a_{\text{in},1}(t) = b_{\text{in},1}e^{-i(\omega_p t + \psi_1)}$$

LHS:

$$[i(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + \gamma + (iK + \gamma_3)B^2]Be^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)}$$

RHS:

$$-i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}b_{\text{in},1}e^{i\phi_1}e^{-i(\omega_p t + \psi_1)}$$

Equating both sides:

$$[i(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + \gamma + (iK + \gamma_3)B^2]B = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}b_{\text{in},1}e^{i(\phi_1 + \phi_B - \psi_1)} \quad (61)$$

Deriving Output Field from the input-output relation:

$$a_{\text{out},1}(t) = a_{\text{in},1}(t) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}e^{-i\phi_1}A(t)$$

Substituting $a_{\text{out},1}(t) = b_{\text{out},1}e^{-i(\omega_p t + \psi_1)}$:

$$b_{\text{out},1}e^{-i(\omega_p t + \psi_1)} = b_{\text{in},1}e^{-i(\omega_p t + \psi_1)} - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}e^{-i\phi_1}Be^{-i(\omega_p t + \phi_B)}$$

We finally get:

$$b_{\text{out},1} = b_{\text{in},1} - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1}Be^{-i(\phi_1 + \phi_B - \psi_1)} \quad (62)$$

Derivation of the cubic equation

Given:

$$[i(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + \gamma]B + (iK + \gamma_3)B^3 = -i2\gamma_1 b_{\text{in},1}e^{i(\phi_1 + \phi_B - \psi_1)} \quad (63)$$

Define:

$$E = |B|^2 = BB^*, \quad \text{so that } |B^3|^2 = E^3$$

Let us define:

$$A = i(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + \gamma, \quad C = iK + \gamma_3, \quad F = -i2\gamma_1 b_{\text{in},1}e^{i(\phi_1 + \phi_B - \psi_1)}$$

Then it becomes:

$$AB + CB^3 = F$$

Take the complex conjugate:

$$A^*B^* + C^*(B^*)^3 = F^*$$

Multiply the equation by its complex conjugate:

$$(AB + CB^3)(A^*B^* + C^*(B^*)^3) = FF^*$$

Expand the left-hand side:

$$|A|^2|B|^2 + AC^*|B|^2(B^*)^2 + A^*C|B|^2B^2 + |C|^2|B|^6$$

Factor using $E = |B|^2$ and $B^2 = Ee^{2i\theta}$, $(B^*)^2 = Ee^{-2i\theta}$:

$$|A|^2E + AC^*E^2e^{-2i\theta} + A^*CE^2e^{2i\theta} + |C|^2E^3$$

Group the complex terms:

$$|A|^2E + 2E^2\Re(AC^*) + |C|^2E^3 = |F|^2$$

Now compute the coefficients explicitly:

$$|A|^2 = \gamma^2 + (\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2$$

$$|C|^2 = \gamma_3^2 + K^2$$

$$\Re(AC^*) = \gamma\gamma_3 + (\omega_0 - \omega_p)K$$

$$|F|^2 = (2\gamma_1 b_{\text{in},1})^2 = 4\gamma_1^2(b_{\text{in},1})^2$$

Substituting back into the equation:

$$E(\gamma^2 + (\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2) + 2E^2[\gamma\gamma_3 + (\omega_0 - \omega_p)K] + E^3(\gamma_3^2 + K^2) = 4\gamma_1^2(b_{\text{in},1})^2 \quad (64)$$

Dividing through by $\gamma_3^2 + K^2$ to get a normalized cubic equation:

$$E^3 + 2\frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)K + \gamma\gamma_3}{K^2 + \gamma_3^2}E^2 + \frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2 + \gamma^2}{K^2 + \gamma_3^2}E = \frac{4\gamma_1^2(b_{\text{in},1})^2}{K^2 + \gamma_3^2}$$

Rewriting in standard form, we obtain:

$$E^3 + 2\frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)K + \gamma\gamma_3}{K^2 + \gamma_3^2}E^2 + \frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2 + \gamma^2}{K^2 + \gamma_3^2}E - \frac{4\gamma_1^2(b_{\text{in},1})^2}{K^2 + \gamma_3^2} = 0 \quad (65)$$

Derivation of $\frac{dE}{d\omega_p}$ and Resonance Peak Condition

We start from the cubic equation for the energy $E = |B|^2$ of the form:

$$E^3 + \frac{2[(\omega_0 - \omega_p)K + \gamma\gamma_3]}{A}E^2 + \frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2 + \gamma^2}{A}E - \frac{2\gamma_1|b_{\text{in},1}|^2}{A} = 0$$

Define:

$$\Delta = \omega_0 - \omega_p, \quad A = K^2 + \gamma_3^2$$

Then the equation becomes:

$$f(E, \omega_p) = E^3 + \frac{2(\Delta K + \gamma\gamma_3)}{A}E^2 + \frac{\Delta^2 + \gamma^2}{A}E - \frac{2\gamma_1|b_{\text{in},1}|^2}{A} = 0$$

To find the condition for the resonance peak, we differentiate implicitly with respect to ω_p :

$$\frac{df}{d\omega_p} = \frac{\partial f}{\partial E} \cdot \frac{dE}{d\omega_p} + \frac{\partial f}{\partial \omega_p} = 0 \Rightarrow \frac{dE}{d\omega_p} = -\frac{\frac{\partial f}{\partial \omega_p}}{\frac{\partial f}{\partial E}}$$

Computing the partial derivatives:

a) *Derivative with respect to E:*

$$\frac{\partial f}{\partial E} = 3E^2 + \frac{4(\Delta K + \gamma\gamma_3)}{A}E + \frac{\Delta^2 + \gamma^2}{A}$$

b) *Derivative with respect to ω_p :* Since $\frac{d\Delta}{d\omega_p} = -1$, we get

$$\frac{\partial f}{\partial \omega_p} = \frac{2K(-1)}{A}E^2 + \frac{2\Delta(-1)}{A}E = -\frac{2K}{A}E^2 - \frac{2\Delta}{A}E$$

c) Substituting:

$$\frac{dE}{d\omega_p} = \frac{2KE^2 + 2\Delta E}{A \left[3E^2 + \frac{4(\Delta K + \gamma\gamma_3)}{A}E + \frac{\Delta^2 + \gamma^2}{A} \right]}$$

Factoring the numerator:

$$\frac{dE}{d\omega_p} = \frac{2E(KE + \Delta)}{A \left[3E^2 + \frac{4(\Delta K + \gamma\gamma_3)}{A}E + \frac{\Delta^2 + \gamma^2}{A} \right]} \quad (66)$$

d) Condition for Maximum Response: Setting $\frac{dE}{d\omega_p} = 0$. This occurs when the numerator of eq. 66 is zero:

$$2E(KE + \Delta) = 0 \Rightarrow KE + \Delta = 0 \Rightarrow \boxed{\omega_0 - \omega_p + KE = 0}$$

This condition shows that the resonance peak is shifted by the Kerr nonlinearity term KE , consistent with the behavior of Duffing-type nonlinear oscillators.

Calculating $\frac{d\omega_p}{dE}$ and $\frac{d^2\omega_p}{dE^2}$

To find the condition for the resonance peak, we differentiate implicitly with respect to dE :

$$\frac{dE}{dE} = \frac{\partial f}{\partial \omega_p} \cdot \frac{d\omega_p}{dE} + \frac{\partial f}{\partial E} = 0 \Rightarrow \frac{d\omega_p}{dE} = -\frac{\frac{\partial f}{\partial E}}{\frac{\partial f}{\partial \omega_p}}$$

Compute the partial derivatives:

e) Derivative with respect to E :

$$\frac{\partial f}{\partial E} = 3E^2 + \frac{4(\Delta K + \gamma\gamma_3)}{A}E + \frac{\Delta^2 + \gamma^2}{A}$$

f) Derivative with respect to ω_p : Since $\frac{d\Delta}{d\omega_p} = -1$, we get:

$$\frac{\partial f}{\partial \omega_p} = \frac{2K(-1)}{A}E^2 + \frac{2\Delta(-1)}{A}E = -\frac{2K}{A}E^2 - \frac{2\Delta}{A}E$$

We get

$$\frac{d\omega_p}{dE} = \frac{3E^2A + 4(\Delta K + \gamma\gamma_3)E + \Delta^2 + \gamma^2}{E^2[K + 2(\omega_0 - \omega_p)]} \quad (67)$$

In a nonlinear driven resonator, the intracavity field amplitude E depends on the driving (pump) frequency ω_p . The system exhibits bistability, meaning that for a given drive frequency, there may be two stable values of E . The transitions between these bistable states (i.e., switching points) occur at the turning points of the response curve $E(\omega_p)$. These are precisely the points where the slope of the response diverges, i.e., the derivative of the drive frequency with respect to amplitude vanishes.

$$\frac{\partial \omega_p}{\partial E} = 0 \quad (68)$$

Setting the numerator of $\frac{\partial \omega_p}{\partial E}$ to 0, we get :

$$3E^2K^2 + 3E^2\gamma_3^2 + 4EK(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + 4\gamma\gamma_3E + (\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2 + \gamma^2 = 0 \quad (69)$$

$$(\gamma + 2\gamma_3E)^2 = (K^2 + \gamma_3^2)E^2 - (\omega_0 - \omega_p + 2KE)^2 \quad (70)$$

Similarly for $\frac{\partial^2\omega_p}{\partial E^2}$

$$6(K^2 + \gamma_3^2)E + 4[(\omega_0 - \omega_p)K + \gamma\gamma_3] = 0 \quad (71)$$

When both equations Eq. (70) and (71) are satisfied, the two instable points merge into one — the critical point of the Duffing-type nonlinear response. At or near this critical

point, the slope $\partial E/\partial \omega_p$ becomes very large or diverges, which corresponds to a situation of large parametric gain. While large gain is desirable for amplification, operating exactly at the critical point can make the system unstable due to strong sensitivity to perturbation. Therefore, in practice, one aims to design the parametric amplifier such that it operates close to but not inside the bistable region. This ensures high gain while maintaining dynamical stability. Condition for Critical Point: To ensure that a critical point exists (i.e., a point where both derivatives vanish), the following condition must be satisfied:

$$|K| > \sqrt{3}\gamma_3 \quad (72)$$

This implies that the Kerr nonlinearity K must be strong enough compared to the two-photon loss rate γ_3 . If this condition is not satisfied, the system cannot exhibit bistability. At the critical point, the amplitude of the resonator field reaches the value:

$$E_c = \frac{2\gamma}{\sqrt{3}(|K| - \sqrt{3}\gamma_3)} \quad (73)$$

This value diverges as $\gamma_3 \rightarrow |K|/\sqrt{3}$, consistent with the disappearance of bistability at that limit. Critical Detuning is defined as the detuning between the cavity resonance ω_0 and the pump frequency ω_p at the critical point given by:

$$\omega_0 - \omega_p = -\frac{\gamma}{K} \cdot \frac{|K|}{K} \left[4\gamma_3|K| + \frac{\sqrt{3}(K^2 + \gamma_3^2)}{K^2 - 3\gamma_3^2} \right] \quad (74)$$

This expression ensures both first and second derivatives of $\omega_p(E)$ vanish at the critical point. The required input pump amplitude squared to reach the critical point is:

$$|b_{in,1c}|^2 = \frac{4}{3\sqrt{3}} \cdot \frac{\gamma^3(K^2 + \gamma_3^2)}{\gamma_1(|K| - \sqrt{3}\gamma_3)^3} \quad (75)$$

This is the minimum input power required to drive the system into the bistable regime. As γ_3 increases, the required power increases dramatically. Large parametric gain occurs near the critical point, where the system's response is highly sensitive to small changes in drive frequency or amplitude. To avoid instabilities due to bistability, it is desirable to operate close to—but not within—the bistable regime. When $\gamma_3 > |K|/\sqrt{3}$, the bistable region becomes inaccessible, and the system behaves in a monostable manner. The presence of two-photon loss γ_3 modifies the shape and position of the Duffing response curve.

IV. LINEARIZATION

The linearization procedure is used in which the signals entering the input port and the noise entering the loss ports are considered compared to the pump.

$$E^3 + 2 \left[\frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)}{K} \right] E^2 + \left[\frac{(\omega_0 - \omega_p)^2 + \gamma^2}{K^2} \right] E - \frac{2\gamma}{K^2} (b_{in,1})^2 = 0 \quad (76)$$

where the incoming pump amplitude for operation at the critical point is given by

$$(b_{in,1c})^2 = \frac{4}{3\sqrt{3}} \frac{\gamma^2}{|K|} \quad (77)$$

solving equation Eq. (76) for $b_{in,1} = 0.5b_{in,1c}$, $\omega_0 = 100e^9$, $K = -9.99e^{-5}\omega_0$ and $\gamma = 0.0032\omega_0$ gives us the following plots where detuning ratio $y = \omega_0 - \omega_p/\omega_0$.

The Heisenberg-Langevin Equation is given by:

$$\frac{da}{dt} + Wa + Va^\dagger = F \quad (78)$$

here

- W is a complex damping parameter,
- V is a complex gain (or squeezing) parameter,
- $F(t)$ is the driving noise/input operator.

$E = B^2$ and

$$W = i(\omega_0 - \omega_p) + \gamma + 2iKB^2 \quad (79)$$

$$V = iKB^2 e^{-2i\phi_B} \quad (80)$$

$$F = -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{i\phi_1} c_{in,1} \quad (81)$$

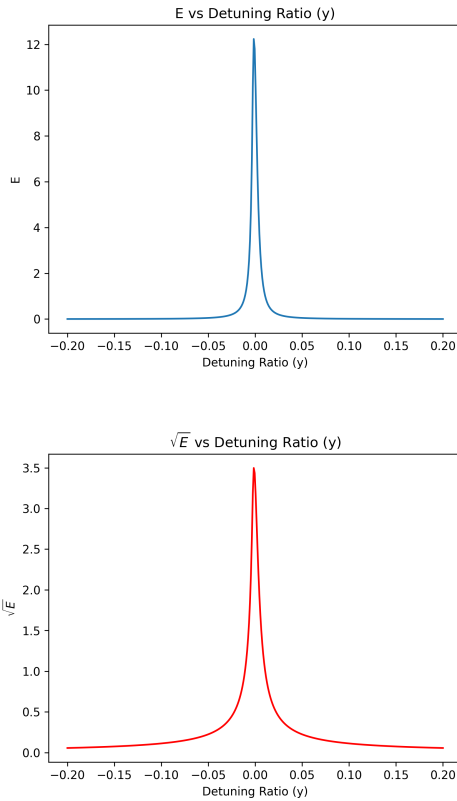


Fig. 2: E vs Detuning Ratio and $\sqrt{E}$ vs Detuning Ratio

Differentiating the linearized equation with respect to time t :

$$\frac{d^2a}{dt^2} + W\frac{da}{dt} + \frac{d(Wa)}{dt} + \frac{d(Va^\dagger)}{dt} = \frac{dF}{dt}$$

$$\frac{d^2a}{dt^2} + W\frac{da}{dt} + \frac{dW}{dt}a + W\frac{da}{dt} + \frac{dV}{dt}a^\dagger + V\frac{da^\dagger}{dt} = \frac{dF}{dt}$$

Collecting like terms:

$$\frac{d^2a}{dt^2} + 2W\frac{da}{dt} + \left(\frac{dW}{dt} + \frac{dV}{dt} + W^2 - V^2\right)a = \frac{dF}{dt} + W^*F - VF^\dagger(t)$$

This reduces to:

$$\frac{d^2a}{dt^2} + 2\Re(W)\frac{da}{dt} + (|W|^2 - |V|^2)a = \Gamma(t)$$

where:

$$\Gamma(t) = \frac{dF}{dt} + W^*F - VF^\dagger(t) \quad (82)$$

Solving the Homogeneous Equation by assuming a solution of the form $a = e^{-\lambda t}$:

$$\frac{d^2a}{dt^2} + 2\Re(W)\frac{da}{dt} + (|W|^2 - |V|^2)a = 0$$

Substituting $a = e^{-\lambda t}$ gives:

$$\lambda^2 - 2\Re(W)\lambda + (|W|^2 - |V|^2) = 0$$

This is a quadratic equation in λ , and its roots are:

$$\lambda_{0,1} = \Re(W) \pm \sqrt{\Re^2(W) - (|W|^2 - |V|^2)}$$

Substituting the expressions for W and V :

$$\lambda_0 = \gamma - \sqrt{K^2B^4 - (\omega_0 - \omega_p + 2KB^2)^2} \quad (83)$$

$$\lambda_1 = \gamma + \sqrt{K^2B^4 - (\omega_0 - \omega_p + 2KB^2)^2} \quad (84)$$

Critical Slowing Down: When the root λ_0 becomes zero.

$$\Re(W) = \sqrt{\Re^2(W) - (|W|^2 - |V|^2)} \quad (85)$$

This condition corresponds to critical slowing down, which occurs when the slope of E with respect to ω_p becomes infinite.

FOURIER TRANSFORM OF THE TIME-DOMAIN EQUATION

We begin with the second-order differential equation in the time domain:

$$\frac{d^2a(t)}{dt^2} + 2\Re(W)\frac{da(t)}{dt} + (|W|^2 - |V|^2)a(t) = \Gamma(t) \quad (86)$$

Our goal is to transform this into the frequency domain using the Fourier transform.

Fourier Transform Properties

Let $f(t) \xrightarrow{\mathcal{F}} f(\omega)$ denote the Fourier transform. The following properties are used:

$$\mathcal{F}\left[\frac{df(t)}{dt}\right] = i\omega f(\omega) \quad (87)$$

$$\mathcal{F}\left[\frac{d^2f(t)}{dt^2}\right] = -\omega^2 f(\omega) \quad (88)$$

$$\mathcal{F}[a(t)] = a(\omega) \quad (89)$$

$$\mathcal{F}[\Gamma(t)] = \Gamma(\omega) \quad (90)$$

Term-by-Term Fourier Transform of Equation

Apply the Fourier transform to each term:

- First term:

$$\mathcal{F}\left[\frac{d^2a(t)}{dt^2}\right] = -\omega^2 a(\omega)$$

- Second term:

$$\mathcal{F}\left[2\Re(W)\frac{da(t)}{dt}\right] = 2i\omega \Re(W)a(\omega)$$

- Third term:

$$\mathcal{F}\left[(|W|^2 - |V|^2)a(t)\right] = (|W|^2 - |V|^2)a(\omega)$$

- Right-hand side:

$$\mathcal{F}[\Gamma(t)] = \Gamma(\omega)$$

Putting it All Together

Substituting all the transformed terms into Eq. (70):

$$-\omega^2 a(\omega) + 2i\omega \Re(W) a(\omega) + (|W|^2 - |V|^2) a(\omega) = \Gamma(\omega) \quad (91)$$

Factor out $a(\omega)$:

$$[-\omega^2 + 2i\omega \Re(W) + (|W|^2 - |V|^2)] a(\omega) = \Gamma(\omega) \quad (92)$$

Final Expression for $a(\omega)$

Solve for $a(\omega)$:

$$a(\omega) = \frac{\Gamma(\omega)}{-\omega^2 + 2i\omega \Re(W) + |W|^2 - |V|^2} \quad (93)$$

The denominator is a quadratic in ω , and its structure resembles a Lorentzian resonance, with:

- Damping determined by $2\Re(W)$,
- Resonant frequency shift influenced by $|W|^2$,
- Parametric interaction encoded in $|V|^2$.

Peaks in the magnitude $|a(\omega)|$ occur near the frequencies where the denominator approaches zero — indicating resonance behavior.

EXPRESSION OF $a(\omega)$ IN TERMS OF CHARACTERISTIC ROOTS

Starting from the frequency-domain solution:

$$a(\omega) = \frac{\Gamma(\omega)}{-\omega^2 + 2i\omega \Re(W) + |W|^2 - |V|^2} \quad (94)$$

We aim to factor the quadratic denominator in terms of its characteristic roots.

Characteristic Equation

Define the characteristic polynomial:

$$\lambda^2 - 2\Re(W)\lambda + (|W|^2 - |V|^2) = 0 \quad (95)$$

λ_0 and λ_1 are the roots. Then:

$$\lambda_0 + \lambda_1 = 2\Re(W), \quad \lambda_0 \lambda_1 = |W|^2 - |V|^2$$

Factoring the Denominator

we see that:

$$-\omega^2 + 2i\omega \Re(W) + |W|^2 - |V|^2 \quad (96)$$

$$= (-i\omega)^2 + 2(-i\omega) \Re(W) + |W|^2 - |V|^2 \quad (97)$$

$$= (-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1) \quad (98)$$

Final Expression

Thus, we can rewrite $a(\omega)$ as:

$$a(\omega) = \frac{\Gamma(\omega)}{(-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1)} \quad (99)$$

This form highlights the system's frequency response in terms of its complex poles λ_0 and λ_1 , which govern resonance and damping behavior.

DERIVATION OF $\Gamma(t)$ AND $\Gamma(\omega)$ FOR THE HEISENBERG-LANGEVIN EQUATION

We know

$$\Gamma(t) = \frac{dF}{dt} + W^* F(t) - V F^\dagger(t). \quad (100)$$

Define the Fourier transform:

$$F(t) = \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} \frac{d\omega}{2\pi} e^{-i\omega t} F(\omega).$$

Then,

$$\frac{dF}{dt} \rightarrow -i\omega F(\omega), \quad F^\dagger(t) \rightarrow F^\dagger(-\omega).$$

Hence, Eq. (100) becomes

$$\Gamma(\omega) = (-i\omega + W^*)F(\omega) - V F^\dagger(-\omega). \quad (101)$$

Derivation of $\Gamma(\omega)$ with three input ports. Given the time-domain operators and their Fourier transforms,

$$a(t) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}} \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} d\omega a(\omega) e^{-i\omega t}, \quad (102)$$

$$(103)$$

$$c_j(t) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}} \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} d\omega c_j(\omega) e^{-i\omega t}, \quad j = 1, 2, 3. \quad (104)$$

The operator $F(t)$, representing environmental noise/input, can be decomposed into contributions from three ports:

$$F(t) = \sum_{j=1}^3 f_j(t), \quad (105)$$

where each component is

$$f_j(t) = \sqrt{\gamma_j} e^{i\phi_j} c_{in,j}(t). \quad (106)$$

Here,

- γ_j is the coupling rate for port j ,
- ϕ_j is the associated phase,
- $c_{in,j}(t)$ is the input annihilation operator for port j .

Since c_3 is driven by a pump at frequency ω_p , its operators appear with shifted frequencies $\omega_p \pm \omega$ and an additional phase ϕ_B due to the pump. Thus,

$$F(t) = \sqrt{\gamma_1} e^{i\phi_1} c_{in,1}(t) + \sqrt{\gamma_2} e^{i\phi_2} c_{in,2}(t) + \sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}(t). \quad (107)$$

Taking the Fourier transform,

$$F(\omega) = \sqrt{\gamma_1} e^{i\phi_1} c_{in,1}(\omega) + \sqrt{\gamma_2} e^{i\phi_2} c_{in,2}(\omega) + \sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}(\omega). \quad (108)$$

For the third port, due to the pump frequency,

$$c_{in,3}(\omega_p + \omega), \quad c_{in,3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega) \quad (109)$$

are the relevant operators.

$$F^\dagger(-\omega) = \sqrt{\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} c_{in,1}^\dagger(-\omega) + \sqrt{\gamma_2} e^{-i\phi_2} c_{in,2}^\dagger(-\omega) + \sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{-i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega) \quad (110)$$

Starting from

$$\Gamma(\omega) = (-i\omega + W^*)F(\omega) - V F^\dagger(-\omega), \quad (111)$$

substitute the expressions for $F(\omega)$ and $F^\dagger(-\omega)$:

$$\begin{aligned} \Gamma(\omega) = & (-i\omega + W^*) [\sqrt{\gamma_1} e^{i\phi_1} c_{in,1}(\omega) + \sqrt{\gamma_2} e^{i\phi_2} c_{in,2}(\omega) \\ & + \sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}(\omega_p + \omega)] \\ & - V [\sqrt{\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} c_{in,1}^\dagger(-\omega) + \sqrt{\gamma_2} e^{-i\phi_2} c_{in,2}^\dagger(-\omega) \\ & + \sqrt{\gamma_3} e^{-i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega)] \end{aligned} \quad (112)$$

Pulling out the common factors to match standard

input-output theory conventions:

$$\begin{aligned} \Gamma(\omega) = & -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{i\phi_1} c_{in,1}(\omega)] \\ & + i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} V e^{-i\phi_1} c_{in,1}^\dagger(-\omega) \\ & -i\sqrt{2\gamma_2} [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{i\phi_2} c_{in,2}(\omega)] \\ & + i\sqrt{2\gamma_2} V e^{-i\phi_2} c_{in,2}^\dagger(-\omega) \\ & -i2\sqrt{\gamma_3 B} [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}(\omega_p + \omega)] \\ & + i2\sqrt{\gamma_3 B} V e^{-i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in,3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega) \end{aligned} \quad (113)$$

- The factor $2\sqrt{\gamma_3 B}$ for the third port reflects the parametric drive strength B .
- The phases ϕ_j and ϕ_B arise from the physical setup.
- The frequency shifts $\omega_p \pm \omega$ on the third port reflect pump-induced sidebands.

We know that the output field can be expressed as

$$c_{out1}(\omega) = c_{in1}(\omega) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} a(\omega), \quad (114)$$

We get:

$$c_{out1}(\omega) = c_{in1}(\omega) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} \cdot \frac{\Gamma(\omega)}{(-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1)}$$

Define the denominator:

$$D(\omega) = (-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1) \quad (115)$$

Then:

$$c_{out1}(\omega) = \frac{D(\omega)c_{in1}(\omega) - i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} \Gamma(\omega)}{D(\omega)}$$

Now plug in $\Gamma(\omega)$ from Eq. (112). We expand the expression:

$$-i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} \Gamma(\omega)$$

And break it into parts:

Term 1:

$$\begin{aligned} & -i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} e^{-i\phi_1} \cdot \left(-i\sqrt{2\gamma_1} [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{i\phi_1} c_{in1}(\omega) - V e^{-i\phi_1} c_{in1}^\dagger(-\omega)] \right) \\ & = 2\gamma_1 [(-i\omega + W^*)c_{in1}(\omega) - V e^{-2i\phi_1} c_{in1}^\dagger(-\omega)] \end{aligned}$$

Term 2:

$$\begin{aligned} & -i\sqrt{2\gamma_2} e^{-i\phi_1} \cdot \left(-i\sqrt{2\gamma_2} [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{i\phi_2} c_{in2}(\omega) - V e^{-i\phi_2} c_{in2}^\dagger(-\omega)] \right) \\ & = 2\gamma_1 \gamma_2 [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{-i(\phi_1 - \phi_2)} c_{in2}(\omega) - V e^{-i(\phi_1 + \phi_2)} c_{in2}^\dagger(-\omega)] \end{aligned}$$

Term 3:

$$\begin{aligned} & -i\sqrt{2\gamma_3} e^{-i\phi_1} \cdot \left(-i\sqrt{2\gamma_3 B} [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in3}(\omega_p + \omega) \right. \\ & \quad \left. - V e^{-i(\phi_B + \phi_3)} c_{in3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega)] \right) \\ & = 2\gamma_1 \gamma_3 B [(-i\omega + W^*)e^{-i(\phi_1 - \phi_B - \phi_3)} c_{in3}(\omega_p + \omega) \\ & \quad - V e^{-i(\phi_1 + \phi_3 + \phi_B)} c_{in3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega)] \end{aligned}$$

We obtain:

$$\begin{aligned} c_{out1}(\omega) = & \frac{1}{(-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1)} \left[\right. \\ & (-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1) c_{in1}(\omega) \\ & - 2\gamma_1 (-i\omega + W^*) c_{in1}(\omega) \\ & + 2\gamma_1 V e^{-2i\phi_1} c_{in1}^\dagger(-\omega) \\ & - 2\sqrt{\gamma_1 \gamma_2} (-i\omega + W^*) e^{-i(\phi_1 - \phi_2)} c_{in2}(\omega) \\ & + 2\sqrt{\gamma_1 \gamma_2} V e^{-i(\phi_1 + \phi_2)} c_{in2}^\dagger(-\omega) \\ & - 2\sqrt{2\gamma_1 \gamma_3 B} (-i\omega + W^*) e^{-i(\phi_1 - \phi_B - \phi_3)} c_{in3}(\omega_p + \omega) \\ & \left. + 2\sqrt{2\gamma_1 \gamma_3 B} V e^{-i(\phi_1 + \phi_3 + \phi_B)} c_{in3}^\dagger(\omega_p - \omega) \right] \quad (116) \end{aligned}$$

Two important scenarios that are calculated in the next section are:

- 1) Intermodulation gain: Only the input signal $c_{in1}^\dagger(-\omega)$ is present. This corresponds to a classical signal at frequency $\omega_p - \omega$, which leads to an output signal at frequency $\omega_p + \omega$.
- 2) Parametric gain: Only the input signal $c_{in1}(\omega)$ is present. This corresponds to a classical signal at frequency $\omega_p + \omega$.

V. INTERMODULATION GAIN

Using the third term in Eq. (114) we can calculate the Intermodulation Gain to be :

$$G_I \equiv \frac{|c_{out,1}(\omega)|^2}{|c_{in,1}(-\omega)|^2} = \frac{4\gamma^2 |V|^2}{(\omega^2 + \lambda_0^2)(\omega^2 + \lambda_1^2)} \quad (117)$$

We plot the intermodulation gain ($\omega = 0$) as follows

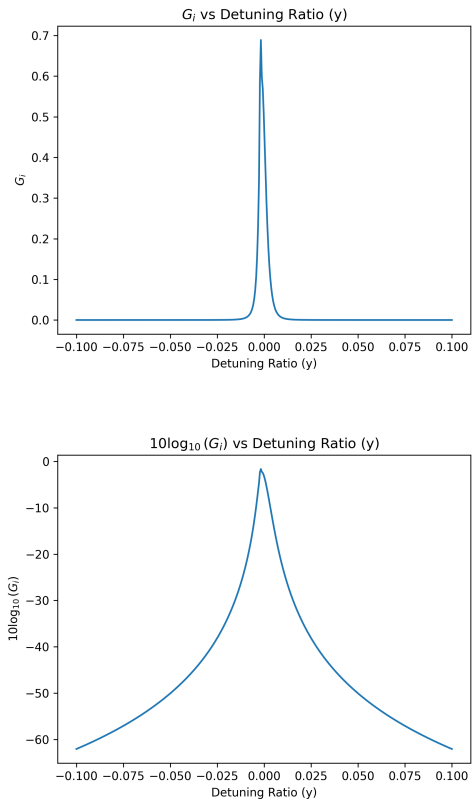


Fig. 3: Intermodulation Gain vs Detuning Ratio

VI. PARAMETRIC GAIN

We calculate the Parametric Gain to be :

$$G_S \equiv \frac{|c_{out,1}(\omega)|^2}{|c_{in,1}(\omega)|^2} = \frac{|(-i\omega + \lambda_0)(-i\omega + \lambda_1) - 2\gamma(-i\omega + W^*)|^2}{(\omega^2 + \lambda_0^2)(\omega^2 + \lambda_1^2)} \quad (118)$$

For a pump amplitude of $b_{in,1} = 0.8b_{in,1c}$ the plots for parametric gain is depicted below in figure 4.

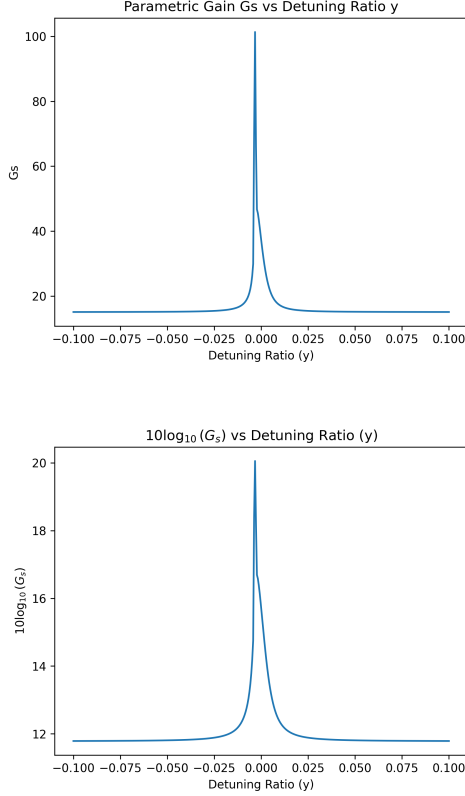


Fig. 4: Parametric Gain vs Detuning Ratio

VII. CONCLUSION

This paper presented a theoretical review of a cavity parametric amplifier that exhibits both Kerr nonlinearity and two-photon loss. The presence of a Kerr nonlinearity introduces a nonlinear dependence of the cavity resonance frequency on the intracavity field amplitude, while the two-photon loss adds a nonlinear damping mechanism.

Expressions were derived and plotted for:

- The intracavity pump amplitude.
- The reflected pump amplitude.
- The parametric gain, which characterizes amplification at the input signal frequency.
- The intermodulation gain, which accounts for signal generation at frequencies different from the input.

These results are obtained under the assumption that pump saturation can be neglected. The analytical expressions serve as practical tools for fitting experimental data and extracting key model parameters, such as the Kerr coefficient K , linear loss γ , and two-photon loss rate γ_3 . Importantly, we find that the presence of two-photon loss significantly modifies the system's behavior. It increases the input power required to reach the bistable regime. The bistable regime ceases to exist when the two-photon loss rate exceeds a critical value and the resonance curve no longer exhibits the characteristic S-shape, and the system

becomes monostable. This result implies that careful tuning of the Kerr nonlinearity and the two-photon loss rate is necessary for accessing and exploiting the nonlinear gain and bistability features in parametric amplifiers.

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